

Reading Notes

Nikolaos Vichos

1 Kingzette et al. (2021): US

1.1 Contribution

- Find strong support for a cue-taking mechanism where affectively polarized partisans might oppose constitutional protections when their party is in power but support them when their party is out of power.
- Find no support for a mechanism that affective polarization might generate biases that lead to intolerance and, as a result, restriction of the other party's rights.

1.2 Theory

Two potential mechanisms connecting affective polarization and opposition to democratic norms

1. Politicization of norms due to elite rhetoric: Affective polarization → Elites in power, especially in situations of affective polarization, oppose democratic norms because they limit their power, whereas elites in opposition signal support for them, to limit governing elites' power) → Voters receive a clear partisan cue as to whether they should support these norms, according to whether their party controls the White House or not.
 - Norms thus stop being fundamental principles, and become “rules that only apply to the other party” (Kingzette et al. 2021, 666)
 - These cues are heightened under affective polarization because polarized partisans feel the need to distinguish themselves from the other party.
2. Affective polarization → Partisans seen the outparty as a threat → They want to limit its democratic rights in order to make it less likely that it gains power and implements a threatening agenda

1.3 Conception of democracy

Takes an approach that most closely resembles the measurement of the ‘liberal’ components of liberal democracy, focusing on (1) constitutional protections (separation of powers, checks and balances, and authoritarian tendencies) and (2) political tolerance (belief in equal social rights for all citizens). Again, this is a relatively ‘middle of the road’ approach that is not so maximalist as to include only economic inequality measures but also not so minimalist as to include only measures of electoral democracy (though these measures might be becoming more relevant after the questioning of the 2020 election results).

1.4 Research Design

US-based, observational design with a sample size of almost three thousand in 2019. Also makes use of the American Panel Survey to test whether this applies under Democrat rule in 2012.

- Regression of affective polarization on democratic norms, partisanship, and an interaction term
- **Potential issue:** Different ‘background’ affective polarization in 2012 vs 2016 influencing the results.

Measures:

- IV: Affective polarization, using three component items for an index (feeling thermometer scales toward parties (not partisans), trait ratings of the parties, partisan trust measure, and social distance measure). Measures affective polarization as the difference between outparty and inparty affect.
 - **Potential issues:** Might not make much sense to aggregate, even with a high Cronbach’s alpha, because, with the exception of the first item, the items mostly measure partisans’ attitudes toward other partisans (rather than the party elites, which in fact is not measure explicitly by the thermometer)
- Support for democratic norms: items along two dimensions of democracy (constitutional protections and political tolerance) that avoided cueing partisanship
 - **Potential issues:** No inclusion of items measuring rule of law (leaders facing consequences for misconduct), and their might be some replication and over-emphasis on the ‘strong and unitary executive’ element, measured both 2/5 items (though it also makes sense, because of the centrality of executive authority in their theoretical argument).

Potential issue:

- Mechanism does not really test for whether the norms really start from the elites and then are adopted by the ordinary citizens. Thus, the elite-driven part of the mechanism is more assumed than proven.
- Also, given that the second mechanism is mostly driven by outgroup hostility, a measure of polarization that only includes that (and not ingroup affection, as in Voelkel et al. (2023)) as a robustness check might have made sense.

1.5 Results

1.5.1 Mechanism 1 on cue-taking and politicized norms:

- Significant results across the five constitutional protection items:
 - Democrats were more supportive of democratic norms when not in power.
 - Republicans were less supportive of democratic norms when in power, except for checks and balances (though this might be due to the divided government, and Republican elites supporting checks and balances when Democrats controlled the house)
- They also find that some of the tolerance items exhibited this phenomenon, suggesting that even norms that were not a focus of elite rhetoric might have been affected
 - **Potential issue:** How could cueing even take place if it was not part of the rhetoric? Seems a bit of stretch, would need to adjust for multiple hypothesis testing

1.5.2 Mechanism 2 on political tolerance:

- No evidence supporting this hypothesis, since there is no generalized relationship between affective polarization and support for norms of political tolerance

1.5.3 Robustness checks

- They also want to examine the effect among more exposed partisans
 - They look at political knowledge, assuming that they would be more likely to know the party's positions (and thus cueing is more likely)
 - * **Potential issue:** They could have also used arguably more useful measures like whether they voted in primaries, in the general election, or if they were registered to vote

- They find that knowledgeable Democrats (Republicans) are more (less) likely to support protections (though checks and balances were supported across everyone).
- However, they do not find consistent effects for the tolerance items
 - * **Potential issue:** It would have been interesting to comment on one of the findings that seems to show the least-knowledgeable Democrats become the *least* democratic of the bunch when polarization is high (especially because they are asking for an executive that get things done, no matter what, which is counter-intuitive under Trump)
- They also check the inverse politicization effect during 2012
 - No measure for affective polarization so they use strength of partisanship
 - They find that:
 - * Strong Republicans are more supportive of democratic norms
 - * But Strong Democrats are *not* (null effect)
 - * **Potential issue:** This *should* be the case if their theory holds, and Democrats in power should be more authoritarian. The presence of partisan asymmetry should have been commented on, since it might link to the history/identity of the two parties
 - They also use 2013 data that look at endorsement of the use of tear gas and find very inverse results.
 - * Affective polarization leads to:
 - Republicans becoming more likely to endorse the use of tear gas
 - Democrats becoming less likely to do so
 - * **Potential issue:**
 - This is weird due to Democrats being in power
 - Might be due to the history/identity of the two parties. This could suggest that the finding is not really about who is in power or not, but rather about partisan asymmetry and fundamental differences between the two parties
 - Might also be due to the specific “priming” of the type of protests taking place at the time (Occupy, or BLM)

1.6 Findings and discussion

- Mechanism 1: Supported by the evidence, points to a politicization-driven decline in norm support through elite cue-taking, where elites either support or oppose democratic norms, according to whether they are in opposition or in government. This elite cue of conditional acceptance or rejection of norms is then adopted by partisans.
- Mechanism 2: No evidence suggesting that partisans will become more intolerant toward their opponents and thus oppose tolerance overall.
- **Additional issues not mentioned:** Could this finding not really be an issue of who is in power or not, but rather about the historical identities of the parties. This is supported by some of the mixed findings in the robustness checks, especially the protest-related one.

2 Broockman, Kalla, and Westwood (2023): US

2.1 Contribution

- Argues that scant attention has been paid to the specific process by which affective polarization can affect political decisions.
- Suggests OVB present in existing research, because people with different levels of affective polarization are likely to differ in many ways. They make up for that through experiments manipulating Americans' levels of affective polarization (4 trust game manipulations + 1 robustness check) and then probing potential consequences

2.2 Findings

- Large downstream effects on general interpersonal questions
- Consistently null findings in five political domains: electoral accountability, adopting one's party policy positions, support for legislative bipartisanship, support for democratic norms, perceptions of objective conditions
- These suggest that efforts to bolster support for democratic norms/accountability by reducing affective polarization might be ineffective

2.3 Theory

- Background: They are skeptical of the model where external considerations → affect of voters toward the party → political choice (through heuristic, relying on affect)
 - There may be other accessible attributes or competing heuristics that might be relevant. Hence, while partisan affect might be present in abstract scenarios, it might not be as present in actual ones.
 - It is costly to allow affective polarization to influence judgements. Their original choice was attractive for a reason, and they will need to surrender that. This explains why affect may have an effect to answers on abstract questions (since there are limited trade-offs) but less of an effect on actual interactions)
- Their theoretical framework of why affective polarization might NOT lead to a (causal) reduction in democratic norms support, even if the two are correlated:
 - Affect might serve to summarize other considerations of partisans. However, these considerations might influence both the affect AND political choices/ support for liberal democratic norms.
 - Since these considerations influence both affect AND political choices, the two might be correlated despite not having a causal relationship—this is basically a case of omitted variable bias.

2.4 Conception of democracy

Does not focus on institutional change like Orhan (2022) but change in support for democratic attitudes.

The democratic attitudes they focus on are:

- Interpersonal items: social distance from outparty items like uncomfortable with outparty neighbors or friends
- Electoral accountability: willingness to hold outpartisans/inpartisans accountable
- Adopting party positions: responsiveness to partisan cues
- Support for legislative bipartisanship
- Perception of objective conditions (COVID deaths, unemployment rate)
- Democratic norms:

- Norms: Compromise, gerrymandering, strong ‘unitary’ executive, judicial independence, press freedom, vote suppression, freedom of protest. Mostly overt violations of democratic rule.
- Violence justification index
- Vignettes: protest suppression, corruption tolerance, antilocution, and overriding election results
- **Potential issues:**
 - Crucially, in the case of the vignettes these are conceptualized and worded mostly as directly targeting the outparty candidates/partisans or favoring the inparty candidate/partisans, rather than broader questions. This reduces abstraction. The vignettes are mostly targeted not against ‘ordinary people’ but elites, thus focusing on a specific type of attitude. They focused on things like protest suppression, corruption tolerance, antilocution, and election override. Relatively unpopular measures already, especially when it comes to corruption tolerance.
 - The issues addressed by the democratic norms concern mostly over violations of democratic rule, rather than more subtle democratic backsliding.

Their conception of democratic norms is not as explicitly mentioned as Kingzette et al. (2021) but it is both minimalist and maximalist in a sense

- Maximalist: They focus on things *beyond* democratic norms in the traditional sense but on things that are quite closely related and quite necessary to the good functioning of a democratic system: responsiveness to elite cues, support for legislative bipartisanship (deliberative democracy), and willingness to hold outpartisans or inpartisans accountable
- Minimalist: The norms they focus on largely concern quite over violations of democratic norms, rather than more subtle ones that often characterize democratic backsliding (with the exception of gerrymandering)

2.5 Research Design

US-based, experimental design, large sample size (over 12,000 participants spanning five surveys), focusing on Americans’ support for democratic norms w

Two stages:

1. Task/interventions that manipulates levels of affective polarization
 - Surveys 1-4: Trust game with member of the opposing party
 - Across four surveys, there is an average increase of 14.3 degrees in affective polarization when exposed to the negative condition.

- **Potential issue** : the effect is driven by out-group rather than in-group affect, with large increases in sentiments toward out-partisans (but also political elites) as a result of the positive condition. An important gap thus concerns the impacts of increasing in-group affect
- Survey 5: Addresses potential issues with previous surveys arising from factors such as obtrusive manipulation, construct validity (trust game affecting measures of polarization but not actual polarization), or the positive experience impacting not only affective polarization but other measures too (and these omitted measures could cancel out the effect).
 - It does so through an intervention that reduces affective polarization by (i) correcting misconceptions about the demographic composition of partisans, (ii) altering perceptions of partisan outviews on an issue, and (iii) prompting partisans to think about an outpartisan friend.
- Then, this is followed manipulations checks to see whether affective polarization actually increased, checked through a number of survey items about the effects of polarization
- **Potential issue** :
 - Decreasing affective polarization through interaction is not a situation in which people might willingly find themselves in (i.e., forcing them to “interact” with an outpartisan)
 - Timing: Existing levels of ‘background’ priming that increased affective polarization within the context of a pre-election period (Surveys 1-3, October-December 2019), immediately after an election (Survey 4, December 2020), and a highly polarized post-election period (Survey 5, June 2021). Also, timing-related, in later stages of polarized societies, it might be more likely to observe these effects

2. Outcomes measuring support for democratic norms, after the manipulation

2.6 Results

2.6.1 Results of Surveys 1-4

- Interpersonal items: Large and significant decreases in these items as a result of the positive condition, suggesting a decrease in animosity (decrease in discomfort)
- Electoral accountability: Affective polarization does not encourage additional electoral accountability directed toward outpartisans or lower electoral accountability toward copartisans

- Adopting party positions (responsiveness to cues): Reducing affective polarization does not lead to respondents adopting their party's positions at lower rates.
- Support for legislative bipartisanship: Less affectively polarized respondents were actually rewarded bipartisanship *less* (effect is insignificant)
- Democratic norms: Consistently null results on political outcomes
- Perceptions of objective conditions: Even though there is partisanship bias in perceptions of the unemployment rate and number of COVID deaths, decreasing affective polarization does *not* mitigate this.

2.6.2 Results for Survey 5

- Reduced affective polarization less than Surveys 1-4.
- Consistently null results on political outcomes, mixed effects on social distance (decreased discomfort but *increased* beliefs that outpartisans should not be hired), suggesting that the causal effects of affective polarization might not be robust to more specific questions but also abstract survey questions.

2.6.3 Experimental vs Endogenous Estimates

- The authors also compare their experimental estimates with non-causal endogenous estimates, computed by estimating the observational relationship between (a) the difference in affective polarization equal to the size the treatment created and (b) the outcomes.
- Affective polarization correlates with a number of outcomes, like policy preferences. This suggests the presence of OVB inflating the correlation, showing how difficult it is to isolate the causal effect of affective polarization.

2.7 Discussion and conclusion

- Affective polarization should not influence all judgments somewhat related to party, but only those judgments where individuals do not have another, readily available and relevant mechanism/heuristic.
- In order for affective polarization to have an effect, individuals must give up whatever they liked about their initial choice. For abstract survey questions without an impact or trade-off of switching, it might be likely to have an impact.
- Limitations:

- Immediate effects of affective polarization, instead of long-term or indirect effects. By reducing interactions, affective polarization could have a catch-22 effect that indirectly effects people's attitudes.
- Manipulations primarily decreased outpartisan dislike rather than inpartisan support.
- Implications
 - Future research should look at the interpersonal domain: specific judgments involve trade-offs, unlike abstract survey questions. It should also look into areas where the interpersonal domain and the political are linked: reducing affective polarization made citizens more likely to deliberate with outpartisans, which could have important consequences.
 - Attempts to reduce affective polarization might not be an effective way to reverse a decline in support for democratic norms.

3 Orhan (2022): Comparative

3.1 Main argument:

- Affective polarization → rise in political cynicism and tolerance and partisan loyalty → crossing party lines becomes costly → voters are less likely to punish in-party politicians with undemocratic behavior
- Places itself on the micro-side of the explanations of democratic backsliding

3.2 Theory

- **Main framework** : Affective polarization → rise in political cynicism and tolerance and partisan loyalty → crossing party lines becomes costly → voters are less likely to punish in-party politicians with undemocratic behavior (and thus undemocratic behavior is more likely to take place which is what they test for).
 - Or, as they put it: salient partisanship → negative out-party beliefs → partisan loyalty → support for backsliding
 - Some important notes on their framework
 - * Rather than focusing on ideological position as a driver of that effect, affective polarization is about ad hominem attitudes (in fact, ideological polarization need not lead to affective polarization)

- * Backsliding can thus occur even if voters are opposed to undemocratic positions: most voters are partisans first, democrats second.
- * Individuals attach themselves to multiple identity groups: the more salient the identity, the more positive (negative) the in-group (out-group) affect.

3.3 Conception of democracy

They focus on democratic governance, not democratic norms. They define backsliding as the “deterioration of qualities associated with democratic governance”

The specific institutional/governance elements they focus on are the liberal democracy.

- They thus adopt a “middle ground” definition that is neither minimalist (institutional arrangements) or maximalist (representing a broader view that includes social rights, economic inequality, etc.).
- Their definition thus corresponds to V-Dem’s liberal democracy index variable, which includes both a an electoral element (corresponding to Dahl’s polyarchy) and a liberal element (rule of law, civil liberties, etc.)

3.4 Research design

Comparative, not just US. Cross-national study across 53 countries and 170 national election surveys. Observational design

- Method: Observational, using OLS and multi-level models, does *not* use fixed effects because of the small sample size.
- Focuses on liberal democracy (V-dem) as the main outcome variable and measure of democratic backsliding
- For the DV: they construct an affective polarization index, following Reiljan (2020) for multi-party systems that first calculates the affective polarization score for each party group (in-party vs out-party feeling, weighed for party-size), and then sums them up, again weighed by vote-share
- Controls: ideological polarization, economic variables (because of economic inequality), judicial independence scores, and other democratic factors (lagged liberal democracy index scores, past democratic breakdowns, average regional democracy scores)

– **Potential issues :**

- * Judicial independence as a control does not make much sense, since it should be part of the outcome variable construction. If not, then there are construct validity issues.

- * Potential missing control variables (OVB): institutional variables like electoral systems (majoritarian/PR) or presidentialism vs parliamentarism, or party-system characteristics such as the number of parties or the presence of populist parties

3.5 Results

- Consistently significant effects for affective polarization on democratic backsliding, null results for ideological polarization, in line with the authors' hypotheses.
- Robustness tests using different measures (Polity IV, Freedom House) and time-periods over which backsliding could occur agree with that (with the exception of Polity IV).
- Controls were generally insignificant. The significant ones (regional in models 1-6, lagged DV in some other models) are not consistently so, suggesting that these dynamics are not standard.
- The fact that they look at democratic backsliding at $t + 5$ is also supportive of the existence of causality in one way rather than the other, though they do acknowledge that the direction of causality could go the other way around.
- Focusing on different elements of democracy (accountability, individual liberties, deliberation), they find similar results. Unclear what "accountability in general meant)
 - **Potential issues** : This does, in part, test for the mechanism (especially the accountability one), but still, there is no specific link that tests whether support for democratic norms is decreasing, as they key intermediate step.
- * Ironically enough, as much as he says that we need to reassess and refocus on the role of 'ordinary people', he does not really do that directly.

4 Voelkel et al. (2023): US

4.1 Main focus:

- They test the impact of reducing depolarization (three different interviews) on anti-democratic attitudes.

4.2 Theory

- They outline three mechanisms that could explain how reducing polarization could lead to an increase in support for democratic outcomes (though they do not really test for the specific intermediate steps of the mechanisms, except for the increase in empathy for the outpartisans)
 1. Reducing polarization → reduce the threat of the negative consequences when *outparty* win + support for undemocratic *inparty* candidates.
 2. Reducing polarization → reduce identification with the inparty → reduce the desire to win at all costs, including those affecting democracy
 3. Reducing polarization → increase empathy for outpartisans → more difficult to justify violence against them

4.3 Conception of democracy

Again, though they do not specify it as explicitly as Kingzette et al. (2021) or Orhan (2022) their conception is one that mostly concerns support for more subtle, non-overt violations of democratic governance. Hence, it refers generally the liberal components of democracy (with the exceptions of items concerning election integrity directly or violence against outpartisans).

They include three measures of anti-democratic attitudes

1. Support for undemocratic candidates
 - Violation of judicial independence against outpartisan judges
 - Voter suppression
 - Gerrymandering
 - Questioning/not-accepting election results if outpartisans win
 - Violating freedom of the press
 - Freedom of outpartisans to protest
2. Support for partisan violence
 - Threatening and intimidating messages of inpartisans (outpartisans) against outpartisans (inpartisans)
 - Online harassment of inpartisans (outpartisans) against outpartisans (inpartisans)
 - Violence justification for advancing political goals
 - Violence justification for winning more electoral races
3. Prioritizing partisan ends over democratic means

- Inpartisans should do everything they can to hurt outpartisans, even at the country's expense
- Inpartisans should sacrifice economic prosperity to hurt outpartisans
- Gerrymandering to hurt outpartisans, even if technically illegal
- Using FCC to suppress outpartisan media sources
- Inparty elites should use their legal power to prevent outparty elites from running the country effectively/participating in government
- **Potential issues** : Respondents might not be able to separate this from the real-world context, especially given the timing of the studies and the U.S. context. This stands out more in the element questioning election results: Democrats asked whether they would oppose an undemocratic Democrat candidate might think of this *in relation to* the current Republican party, which is already engaging in this action.

4.4 Research design

US-based, experimental design, large sample size (over 8,000 participants spanning three surveys).

Experimental design in two stages

- Intervention to manipulate affective polarization
 - Friendship intervention: thinking of a friend who supports the outparty
 - Misperception correction intervention: correct exaggerated misperceptions about outparty opposition to inparty attempts to pass a policy
 - Warm elite relations interventions: highlight the friendship between a Republican (McCain) and a Democrat (Biden)
 - * **Other potential issues** :
 - Timing: Surveys 1-2 took place during the politicized period or just after
 - Participants: eliminated if independents (could have maybe included leaners?)
 - Measurement: Their main operationalization affective polarization includes only outgroup affect. Though they do include results for the differences measure in the thermometer that are roughly the same (except for study 3), they claim that increasing cold feelings is not normatively desirable, this is not necessarily the case, as it could still lead to a willingness to undermine democratic norms in order to benefit the inparty (not simply to harm the outparty).
- Outcomes measuring affective polarization and support for democratic norms, after the manipulation.

- Three measures of anti-democratic attitudes:
 1. Support for undemocratic candidates
 2. Support for partisan violence
 3. Prioritizing partisan ends over democratic means
- Three measures of polarization:
 1. Negative feeling toward outparty (feeling thermometer)
 - * \textcolor{red}{Potential issues} : Does not account for inparty affect. Though they do include results for the differences measure in the thermometer that are roughly the same (except for study 3), they claim that increasing cold feelings is not normatively desirable, this is not necessarily the case, as it could still lead to a willingness to undermine democratic norms in order to benefit the inparty (not simply to harm the outparty), which is something they also acknowledge in mechanism (2).
 - * **Potential issues** : There is also no clear reference as to whether the score refers to outpartisan elites or ordinary people (broadly says “Republicans”), except for Survey 3 (which used a convenience sample)
 2. Dictator game: Sharing money with outpartisans
 3. Joy of destruction game: Spending money to take money away from outpartisans

4.5 Results

4.5.1 Correlations

First, they conduct correlations between affective polarization and outcomes

- Not consistent: positive correlations in some studies were positive/inexistent in other studies

4.5.2 Impact of interventions on affective polarization:

Overall, the interventions reduced affective polarization across the measures

- Feeling thermometer: All three interventions
- Dictator: Friendship, misperceptions correction (unclear about elite relations)
- Joy of destruction: Friendship intervention (unclear about relations)

4.5.3 Impact of interventions on undemocratic attitudes

- No significant reduction across the three measures for the first two interventions
- Warm elite relations: More support for undemocratic candidates (but not robust to multiple hypothesis testing) and partisan violence, no effect for prioritizing partisan ends over democratic means

4.5.4 Robustness checks

- Bayesian analyses
 - Provided further evidence that the misperception correction intervention did not affect the outcome variables
 - The same applies to the warm elite relations intervention, despite the statistically significant results (since the effects were positive, not negative)
 - **Potential issues** : Unsure about the assumption that H_0 and H_A are equally likely to be true.
- Random effects meta-analyses
 - Support the idea that the tested interventions reduced affective polarization
 - No evidence that they reduced anti-democratic attitudes (though they cannot rule out that there effects, albeit only modest, of a larger ration)
- **Potential issues** : Their robustness testing and adjustment for multiple hypothesis testing is also important.

4.5.5 Possible mediators and moderators: where does the causal chain break?

- *No evidence* that the tested interventions reduced potential mediators for the link between affective polarization and anti-democratic attitudes
 - Examples: strength of party identification, empathy for outpartisans
 - **Potential flaw** : Could have also included political knowledge, given that it could potentially increase sensitivity to party cues

4.6 Findings and discussion

- Depolarization interventions were successful in reducing affective polarization (self-reported and behavioral) but not in reducing undemocratic outcomes.
- Research on depolarization should avoid assuming downstream consequences, and should instead measure them directly. At the same time, interventions against anti-democratic attitudes should be more direct, rather than seeking to treat them through affective polarization.

5 Bibliography

- Broockman, David E., Joshua L. Kalla, and Sean J. Westwood. 2023. “Does Affective Polarization Undermine Democratic Norms or Accountability? Maybe Not.” *American Journal of Political Science* 67 (3): 808–28. <https://doi.org/10.1111/ajps.12719>.
- Kingzette, Jon, James N Druckman, Samara Klar, Yanna Krupnikov, Matthew Levendusky, and John Barry Ryan. 2021. “How Affective Polarization Undermines Support for Democratic Norms.” *Public Opinion Quarterly* 85 (2): 663–77. <https://doi.org/10.1093/poq/nfab029>.
- Orhan, Yunus Emre. 2022. “The Relationship Between Affective Polarization and Democratic Backsliding: Comparative Evidence.” *Democratization* 29 (4): 714–35. <https://doi.org/10.1080/13510347.2021.2008912>.
- Reiljan, Andres. 2020. “‘Fear and Loathing Across Party Lines’ (Also) in Europe: Affective Polarisation in European Party Systems.” *European Journal of Political Research* 59 (2): 376–96. <https://doi.org/10.1111/1475-6765.12351>.
- Voelkel, Jan G., James Chu, Michael N. Stagnaro, Joseph S. Mernyk, Chrystal Redekopp, Sophia L. Pink, James N. Druckman, David G. Rand, and Robb Willer. 2023. “Interventions Reducing Affective Polarization Do Not Necessarily Improve Anti-Democratic Attitudes.” *Nature Human Behaviour* 7 (1): 55–64. <https://doi.org/10.1038/s41562-022-01466-9>.